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Business Communication

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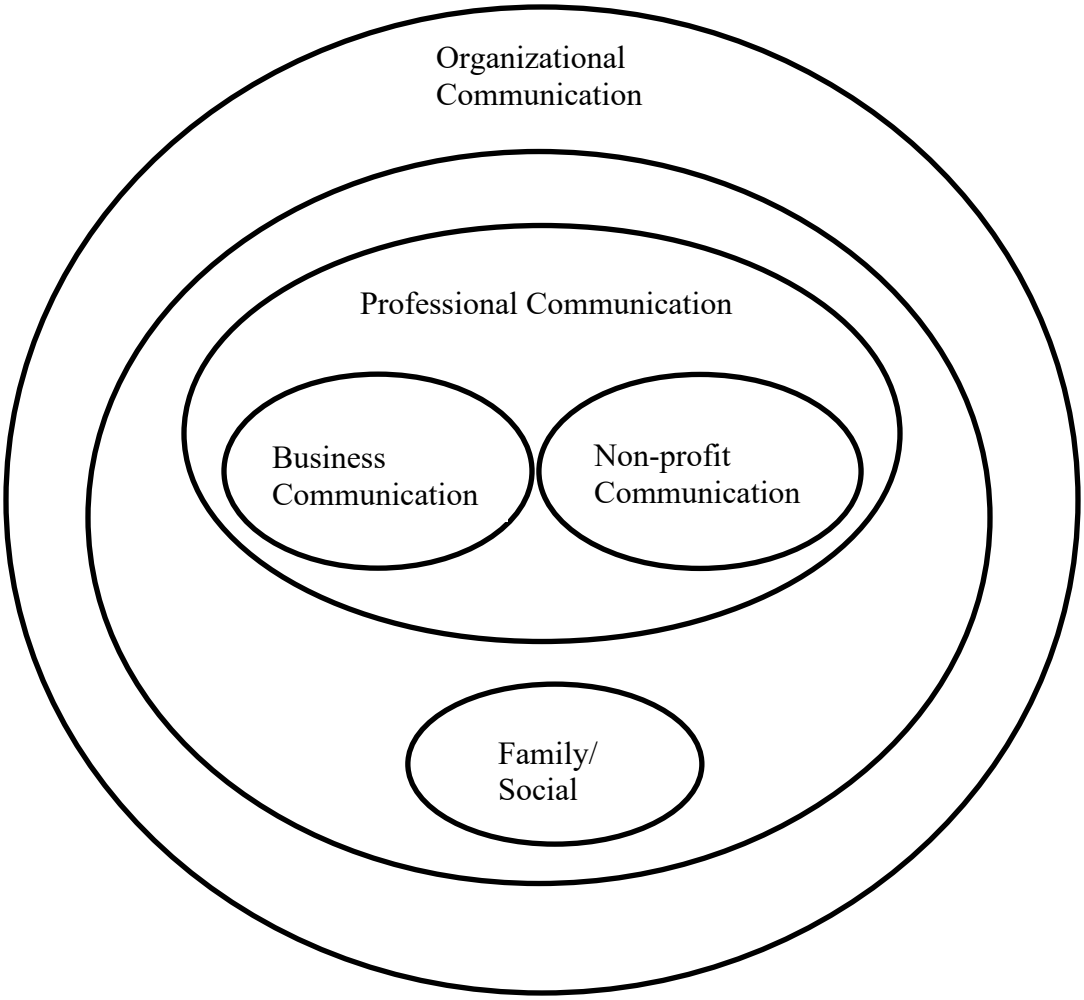
Abstract

Business and professional communication, one aspect of organizational communication, involves intentional messages voluntarily exchanged between two or more people in for-profit companies. Business and professional communication instruction addresses written communication (resumes/cover letters, proposals, reports, formal performance feedback, and electronic messages such as email and material posted online), oral communication (interpersonal, small group/team, and public speaking), and listening. In practice, business and professional communication includes leadership and followership, group decision-making processes, and feedback. Constructivism, expectancy violation theory, and social presence theory encompass three ways to explain and predict business and professional communication. The multi-generational, co-cultural workplace with its increasingly diverse options for creating and delivering messages requires lifelong learning for all employees.

Main Text

Business communication, as a subset of organizational communication, focuses on how two or more people interact in for-profit organizations. These interactions involve exchanging intentional and voluntary messages face to face and via technology/mediated channels. Messages, regardless of context, are designed to achieve one or more communication goals (instrumental, relational, and/or identity). Instrumental goals involve using messages to accomplish a task or achieve an objective. Relational goals are used to create, maintain, and dissolve connections to others in the workplace. Finally, messages that help to create, maintain, or change how others perceive someone at work comprise identity goals. As a subset of organizational communication, business communication is on par with nonprofit (service or volunteer) and social/family organizations (see Figure 1).

Figure 1: Business Communication as Subset of Organizational Communication



Historical Overview

Publications in the *International Journal of Business Communication* (formerly *Journal of Business Communication*) illustrate how this area of research and practice has remained consistent as well as diverged from its roots. For example, in the 1963 inaugural issue, topics included how to teach business communication courses and the importance of effective written messages in the workplace (i.e., resumes and cover letters, memos, company reports, letters). Progressing through the last quarter of the twentieth century, written communication remained an important topic in the journal, However, other topics emphasized using case studies in the classroom, how people responded to messages delivered through various channels (direct mail, phone, computer vs. handwritten), message creation and interpretation (e.g., emotion, motivation, credibility, usage errors), workplace outcomes (e.g., satisfaction, morale, stress),

how technological advancements impact the area of study and practice (e.g., word processors, video, computer, audio teleconferencing), processes (e.g., networking, being an effective subordinate), and public speaking (how to write and present a speech).

The last 20 years has brought the most diversity regarding journal coverage, as many topics and researchers have been internationalized and the broad categories from the first 30 years have expanded. For example, email and video conferencing have been added to the channels covered; telecommuting and negotiation have been added to workplace processes; and message creation and interpretation now includes crisis and health(care) situations. Written messages from the inaugural issue are virtually nonexistent in today's issues. Trending topics include ethics (communication, personal, and organizational), small group/team processes, culturally and socially responsible corporate practices, and communicating strategically. Just as people's work lives have become more complex over the last 50+ years, so has how and what the journal addresses as business communication. Other prominent, relevant publications include *Business and Professional Communication Quarterly*, *Business Communication Quarterly*, and *IEEE Transactions on Professional Communication*.

Instruction

Business and Professional Communication Quarterly highlights the ways though which students learn how to engage in effective business communication. Started less than a decade after the research journal, the 1969 inaugural issue underscores the importance of written communication. Business communication courses can be found in management, business, communication, and English departments on college campuses. Each of these departments brings a unique perspective to the topic. For example, in a business school or department, the course content emphasizes the impact written and oral messages have on the workplace. In the English department, course content highlights the specific words used, particularly as part of written communication. Finally, in a communication department, the emphasis is on developing messages that are tailored to a specific audience to meet their needs and expectations. That is, addressing a group of shareholders about a recent stock-price avalanche is going to call for a different message than providing that same information to a group of assembly-line employees. The former would highlight the action plan and timeline the company is planning to utilize to scale the cliff again. For the blue-collar employees, the president needs to focus on their job security and centrality to keeping the business afloat during the turnaround. No matter where students take the business and/or professional communication course, they should ultimately come to the same conclusions—regardless of whether they place the audience, company, or words first—because all three are central to communicating effectively.

In addition to learning about general messages, business communication instruction covers both written and oral exchanges. In the written communication realm, students learn about writing effective electronic messages, proposals, resumes/cover letters, formal performance feedback, and research (Moshiri & Cardon, 2014). Most written proposals are persuasive in nature; they are written to secure funding for entrepreneurial endeavors, pitch an idea for a client or external audience, or recommend changes to improve the company. There are debates about whether any written messages can be exclusively informative without bleeding over into the persuasive arena. For example, a company's annual report to shareholders and Securities and Exchange

Commission (SEC) filing must contain certain characteristics such as the profit and loss statement, balance sheet, and basic descriptive statistics concerning the business (number of employees, stock price and dividends paid, description of the industry and their business sector); however, it also contains a narrative from management about the previous year's endeavors and a strategic plan for the future. While the audited financial statements and stock price are intended to be factual or informative, how a business presents its place within the industry and the strategic plan are both informative and persuasive. Current and potential shareholders need to be convinced that buying into this organization will result in a positive return on their investment.

Electronic messages have been a burgeoning and continuously evolving area of business communication instruction. As more and more people turn to the internet and companies further develop intranets, writing's importance in the electronic environment has skyrocketed. Whereas people used to write and deliver memos, they now depend upon email to convey that same information. Press releases that were once handed out at press conferences are now sent to media outlets electronically. Hard copies of resumes and cover letters have been replaced by electronic resumes and portfolios. Email and texting are no longer reserved for brick and mortar businesses or friendly time wasting at work. Healthcare sales representatives are entering operating rooms to make sure the doctor has the latest information and support via text to place pins/screws during joint replacement surgeries. Companies are using texting and email to craft effective donor messages to obtain people's time, money, and talents. The rise of social media platforms has transformed how businesses communicate with their various stakeholders.

When it comes to oral communication, students learn how to communicate in interpersonal, group and team, and public situations. Interpersonal communication involves messages exchanged between two or among three people. Small group and team communication involves a limited number of people who have come together to achieve a particular goal. Public communication encompasses oral presentations to a large number of people, usually in a formal environment. These presentations may be: (a) informative, such as a company introducing itself to the local Chamber of Commerce, (b) persuasive, such as a business lobbying local legislatures to change parking or liquor ordinances, or (c). both informative and persuasive, such as a consulting firm presenting the results of a communication audit in which they report on the current state of how communication occurs and convince the leadership to change practices to enhance effective communication. Regardless of how many people are involved, these messages are intentional, delivered verbally, and exchanged in an environment in which people's verbal and nonverbal messages are accessible (face to face, via video-conferencing software/technology such as Skype or FaceTime).

While written and oral communication are taught in almost all business and professional communication courses, listening is taught much less frequently. Given that people are generally poor listeners, honing this skill is essential to performing well in the corporate environment. The 1987 benchmark listening study indicates that people retain approximately 10 percent of the face-to-face messages during interactions; multi-tasking and more reliance on mediated channels are likely decreasing that level of retention and memory (Shellenbarger, 2014). Unless one has a physical impairment, everyone is capable of hearing the message; the next three stages in the process make listening difficult. The listener must interpret the message, which can be harder if the two people speak different languages or dialects of the same language. After interpreting the

message, the person must develop and relay a response. Finally, the messages need to be committed to memory as the final step in the process. Once the four steps have been completed, the listener must also expend time and energy to remain engaged and attentive to the interaction as well as train the brain to be able to retrieve the messages when needed. In an era where most items are searchable online, people's need and desire to strengthen their listening skills has dwindled.

Practice

What is taught and what is practiced in workplaces around the world are not always equivalent. In this case, business communication skills permeate the top-five list that includes leadership, teamwork, written communication, problem-solving skills, and strong ethics (National Association of Colleges and Employers, 2014). In addition to these skills, employees demonstrate effective business communication when they provide feedback to others.

Leadership and Followership

Leadership is one of the most studied topics in organizations. Over time, leadership has progressed from studying the traits that male leaders possess (tall, intelligent, extroverted) to examining the styles leaders use. Communication becomes significantly more important within styles approaches because leaders choose among an autocratic (top-down, focused on command and control), democratic (employees participate in the decision-making processes), or laissez-faire (hands-off and let your employees do their jobs and make their decisions while still being ultimately responsible for their decisions) approach to interacting with followers. More recently, researchers and practitioners have adopted a transformational approach to leadership that is primarily concerned with how leaders communicate. Transformational leaders communicate a vision for the future, serve as a role model, inspire others to achieve greatness, challenge the process by searching for opportunities and taking risks, foster collaboration and strengthen others, and celebrate contributions and small victories. Most recently, leadership researchers have begun examining the specific discourse used by leaders to carry out their role. All of these approaches to leadership focus primarily on the leaders and their behaviors or interactions with others.

On the other side of the coin, followership is studied significantly less than leadership. However, without followers there can be no leaders. Followers choose to follow and do so understanding they are responsible and accountable for actively participating at both the task and relational levels. The earliest leadership theory to take followers into account was situational approaches that looked at the followers' ability and motivation to determine what they needed with respect to leadership (Hersey & Blanchard, 1979). At the earliest development stage, followers needed directive communication to make sure they knew how to accomplish the task and had the motivation to complete the task. Moving forward, the selling communication style, useful when followers are able and not motivated, maintains the formal leader as director and adds two-way communication with input from the followers and support from the leader. At the third developmental stage, participating communication maintains or enhances relationships through increased two-way communication. At the final level where followers are both motivated and

able, delegating communication allows them to use their ability and motivation to their highest potential.

Leaders attend many trainings and workshops on how to be more effective communicators in the workplace. Followership training earns significantly less time and money because businesses often determine they cannot afford to have those followers away from their work to attend such training. Research done from both the followers' and leaders' perspectives has identified key communication characteristics and behaviors that enhance both the relationships and performance. For example, effective followers are willing to question and challenge others as well as have their own thoughts and contributions questioned and challenged. They bring optimism about what the group can achieve by working well together. Effective followers have strong listening, stress management, empathy or perspective-taking, and adaptation skills. They also demonstrate trustworthiness, punctuality, cultural awareness, and a desire to continue improving. Above all, effective followers put group and team goals ahead of individual goals.

Decision-making Processes

Decision-making processes occur most frequently within small groups of 3 to 7 people; however, larger committees of up to 25 people have tried to sit down and come to a decision. These processes include all communication that occurs from the time the problem is defined until all implementation evaluations have occurred. The process's length depends upon a number of factors such as how complex the issue is, how many people are involved, how often/for how long the group works on the problem, the number of constraints to consider when developing a solution, and how well the group members work together.

Generally speaking decision-making processes follow a relatively predictable pattern. While there is some fluidity between the steps and the ability to digress before progressing further, most groups function similarly. First, the group must identify a problem to be solved or opportunity to be considered. Second, group members gather information and resources to determine relevancy to making the decision. Third, members must analyze the situation to determine what limits are placed upon their decision making (e.g., resources such as time, money, intellect, capacity). Brainstorming (Osborn, 1957) options available is the next step in the process. Some groups choose to flip steps three and four so that the constraints are not used as an excuse to generate fewer options or hinder effective outside-the-box thinking. Once the alternatives have been generated, they must be evaluated using an agreed-upon set of criteria. Sixth, the group chooses a preferred alternative and determines the necessary steps/timeline for implementing the decision. Finally, and this is a step often skipped in many groups, the solution and its implementation must be assessed to maximize what went well and avoid similar mistakes in the future.

Decision-making groups encounter many obstacles that slow down their progress. For example, groups are excellent procrastinators when they get caught up in discussions about everything except the issue under consideration. Part of this is a function of a natural tendency to believe there is a large amount of time to complete the task and/or to use the full amount of time allotted by allowing the task to fill as much time as is available. That is, groups with two weeks to complete a task perform similarly to groups that have six weeks because the latter engage in more procrastination and tangential conversations. Second, groups often approach or achieve

groupthink by quickly arriving at a solution without taking all alternatives into consideration or brainstorming long enough to have a healthy list of choices (Janis, 1972). This process is especially prevalent when multiple group members are not actively participating in the decision-making process and simply going along with the group. Group decisions can also result in less responsibility and accountability for poor decisions as each person may blame other group members rather than taking responsibility as one would in an individual decision. A final group pitfall involves trivializing the important aspects of a problem and focusing on the less important minor details. For example, it may take an hour for a company to decide how to spend 1 million dollars on advertising and a day to determine how to handle 10,000 dollars for purchasing new phones.

Feedback

The least utilized business communication tool is informal, positive feedback for employees. Similar to other contexts, saying "thank you" or "job well done" goes a long way to improving employees' morale, satisfaction, and productivity. Also, praise has the largest impact when done in a public situation; effective reprimands or suggestions for performance improvements should always be done in private to allow the employee to save face and make the necessary changes without public humiliation. In reality, many supervisors save all of their performance feedback for annual formal performance appraisals; many of the small issues, which have long since been forgotten, could have been quickly corrected throughout the year. Waiting months to address the larger issues makes them more difficult to correct; it takes very little time to create a bad habit and at least 30 consecutive days to break one, so addressing concerns before they become habitual practices saves the company time and money and potentially maintains a strong working relationship between managers and employees.

Theories

As a field, business communication practices are best explained by theory. Three theories that explain the instruction and practice described above are constructivism, expectancy violations, and social presence. Together, these theories address interpersonal, small group and team, and public aspects of business communication.

Constuctivism

Originating in the 1970s, constructivism postulates that people are going to be more effective communicators when they engage in listener-adapted messages (Delia, 1977). Listener-adapted messages required the message creator to engage in perspective taking to see the situation through the eyes of the listener(s). Creating messages from another's, rather than one's own, perspective requires people to know the people with whom they are communicating. In a business setting, an effective supervisor who has been tasked with motivating employees to participate in and take seriously sexual harassment training must understand their view of sexual harassment specifically and training more generally. If the employees are enthusiastic about attending workplace training because it means time away from the mundaneness of their daily work that will not have to be made up (e.g., people who work in a warehouse do not have to work overtime to complete the boxes that were not packed during training), the message focuses

on the importance and value of training. On the other hand, if the supervisor is trying to motivate salaried employees whose work will still be waiting after the training, a different approach is needed to reach them. The supervisor may need to create an incentive or emphasize a corporate competition for highest-performing unit as central to the motivational message.

Employees often lose sight of perspective taking when they meet with their supervisors. Even though they understand the importance of past experiences, belief systems, emotion, thoughts, and intentions, they often forget to craft a message that takes all of these into consideration in the heat of the moment. For example, an employee's boss has indicated attending a particular training seminar would be beneficial for developing the skills necessary to be promoted. The employee is excited about this prospect and completes the application immediately. Because the employee can check the status online, it is quickly apparent that the boss has not uploaded the endorsement letter. Every two or three days the employee reminds the boss about the letter. After two or three reminders, the boss becomes annoyed and uploads a blank document so that the file will read as complete. The lack of endorsement, which the employee does not know is blank, leads to not being chosen as one of the participants. If the employee had simply remembered that the boss is a procrastinator who encouraged applying and recognized that having someone attend would reflect well on the boss, nagging the boss to upload the letter likely would not have occurred and the boss would likely have written a glowing endorsement.

According to constructivism, messages occur at three levels of listener adaptation. At the lowest, and least effective, level are messages that could be used with any audience regardless of their background or stake in the situation. Also known as mass communication messages (appropriate for all audiences), low-level perspective taking messages tend to be broad, brief, and at approximately an eighth-grade level. At the intermediate, and most often-utilized, level are messages that appeal to a subset of audiences because of one or more shared characteristics. For example, a moderate-level message implies that the audience has been considered but does not explicitly address a person or group of people. It may be appropriate for everyone who is in a supervisor position, but not necessarily all of the employees. Another example of moderate-level messages occurs when companies bring in motivational speakers. These speakers do not change their core messages from business to business or industry to industry, but they may tweak a few aspects of the message to give the appearance of it being written specifically for the hiring company. Finally, the highest-level listener-adapted messages are specifically crafted for an individual audience. These messages utilize all previous knowledge one person has about the other(s) involved in the interaction to craft a personalized message. In an interaction between two restaurant co-workers, the listener-adapted message where one person asks another to take an extra shift may include a reference to specific bills the other person needs to pay, the regulars who come in that night of the week, and personality characteristics, such as being a caring and responsible person.

Research on constructivism and workplace communication has demonstrated a positive relationship between pro-social behaviors, such as perspective taking, and desired outcomes. For example, people who utilize listener-adapted messages tend to be found at higher levels in the organization, have higher salaries, earn more promotions and better performance appraisals, and tend to be transformational leaders (Sypher, Russo, & Hane, 2002). The cognitive complexity that allows them to see people as individuals and adapt their messages to those individuals also

likely serves them well in other organizational situations. They may also see workplace situations from a variety of perspectives that allows them to develop multiple options for solving problems, interacting with diverse people, and/or handling new circumstances.

Expectancy Violation Theory

Expectancy violation theory was initially devised to examine proxemics (nonverbal messages concerning the use of space) (Burgoon & Jones, 1976). As the theory has evolved, it has moved beyond the nonverbal realm to include verbal messages. Essentially, the theory helps researchers and practitioners predict what is going to happen when people break the social norm contracts that exist within a particular culture. Each business has its own culture that lets employees, both new and old, know the way *things work around here*. When engaging in a workplace communication interaction, each person brings an assessment of other(s), the relationship, and the context that determines what expectations the person holds for this specific interaction. When a person or situation is viewed more positively, a larger violation is necessary to trigger one's perception of a violation. When a person or situation is viewed more negatively, a smaller deviation from the social norms is necessary for the person to deem it a violation. Once a violation has occurred, the person's response behavior should be consummate with the perceived gap between expectations and behaviors.

In the workplace, many situations of expectancy violation theory arise. One such situation is with respect to technological communication. For example, what are the social norms or expectations for employees having a personal presence on various social media platforms? At what point does one "cross the line" when engaging in free speech online? Likewise, how long is too long to respond to an email? In an instant-gratification society, particularly for millennials who have grown up with an electronic device within arm's reach, 15 minutes may be too long to respond to an email; for others, how long to respond to an email may be how long it takes to read it and walk down the hall to respond. For still others, more than 24 hours may be too long because their social norm is to check and respond to email once a day to minimize wasted time. Fifteen minutes, one hour, or one day may be too long in different situations that depend upon who is interacting, one's previous experience with this person and the way the person views time. Thus, while expectancies are social norms, those social norms can change depending upon the context, culture, and people interacting.

Outside the online environment, expectancy violations research in the workplace has examined the use of swearing (Johnson & Lewis, 2010). In this research study, the situation (formal or social) and type of messages ("That s@#ks," "Oh sh&t," and "F$%^ off") impact perceptions of whether social norms have been violated in the workplace. That is, in a formal meeting, the third message choice is seen as a grave violation whereas the first message in a social situation is seen as a minor or no violation. In this particular case, the sex and employee status (supervisor or peer) did not impact perceptions of expectancy violations.

Social Presence Theory

Social presence theory was created to explain how connected people feel to each other when communicating via technology (Walther, 1992). Originally, the technology was connecting

people across distance such as employees in different time zones or across continents. However, social presence is also being used to see how people create those connections online when they are in close proximity to each other (between departments or across buildings in larger companies). Social presence spans from superficial connections at one end of the spectrum to deep connections at the other end. The superficial connections often occur between people who are interacting via technology much as strangers would in an I-It relationship. The messages are generally informative and appropriate for any audience (e.g., an email for all employees announcing a computer-system upgrade requiring the network to be down overnight). At the other end of the spectrum, the deepest connections are akin to I-Thou relationships where two people are so well connected to each other that the technology creates no apparent barrier in their communication. While these deeper connections are easier to create when both verbal and nonverbal cues can be observed, it is possible to create them without visually seeing the other person. Most workplace interactions occur somewhere in between purely superficial and purely meaningful connections.

The three dimensions of social presence are affective, cohesive, and interactive. Affective messages share emotions, engage in self disclosure, and use text-speak to replace the nonverbal cues not possible in the electronic environment. Cohesive messages use vocalics (collective pronouns such as "we" or "us" and first names) and phatics (small talk) to strengthen the connection between people. Interactive messages indicate a willingness and interest in communicating with the other(s). Through their language, the technological medium chosen, and communication devices, people develop their social presence. Simply adding more examples of the three message types does not guarantee social presence will be created or enhanced; the three message types are only effective to the extent that they generate an environment more similar to those found in everyday, face-to-face conversations.

The increasingly technological workplace due to tele-commuting, multi-national locations, and travel costs has created a need to examine social presence in both the interpersonal and small group/team context. A study examining the similarities and differences between on- and off-site employees revealed that the social presence and connectivity felt by both groups was similar even though they interact in very different environments (Fonner & Roloff, 2006). They also found that the medium did not dictate levels of social presence—people reported equivalent levels of social presence when communicating face to face or via email, phone, video conferencing, and instant messaging (i.e., texting).

Changing Nature of Business

Multi-generational Workplace

For the first time in history, many workplaces are made up of four generations of employees (Silent, Baby Boomers, Gen X, and Millennials). Having people from all four generations with very different ideas about communication and work has the potential to create stress and lost productivity. Silent generation members believe in hierarchy, value formal, top-down business communication channels, and regard patience as a virtue to be enacted while earning rewards with hard work. Baby Boomers coined the term workaholic due to their competitive and work-hard/play-hard attitudes; they believe anything is possible and see workplaces as succeeding

through formal meetings and structured teams. Generation X, a skeptical group, imposes the greatest self-pressure to prove their worth and craves workplace security as the first group to experience downward mobility in comparison to their parents; their independence encourages decisions without unnecessary meetings or discussion. Finally, Millennials are defined by their lifelong connection to technology; they value informal interactions, group work and connections to others, and change so there are always new experiences. Each of these approaches to work and communication has benefits and drawbacks; the issues arise when employees and companies neglect to recognize and negotiate these differences or visualize the many ways in which these people are all similar in their desire for the business to thrive.

Co-cultural Workplace

During the 1990s and 2000s, the workplace has become increasingly diverse regardless of the metric used to measure diversity. While most of the research on workplace diversity focuses on under-represented groups based upon visible factors such as physical ability, ethnicity or race, and sex, people who bring invisible diversities to businesses are also increasing. Diversity of thought and philosophy can create co-cultural communication opportunities; people who adopt an individualistic view similar to Generation X are likely to collide with people who adopt a collectivistic view similar to the Baby Boomers and Millennials. Another invisible form of diversity has to do with personal relationships. Up until recently, only heterosexual couples could get married and reap the marital insurance benefits afforded in the workplace. With the 2015 Supreme Court ruling allowing same-sex couples to marry and garner those workplace benefits, the divide has been lessened; however, there are still differences between those who are married and those who are single (e.g., assumptions that single people are in a better position to work holidays or overtime because they do not have family with which to spend them, companies contributing more to married employees' benefit packages). Political orientation and spiritual affiliation are additional invisible diversities that people bring to the workplace's interpersonal and team interactions. Visible or invisible, each of these diversities impacts how employees communicate internally and externally.

Traditional vs Emerging Messages

In the recent past, memos, company-wide meetings, and press kits were popular forms of communication; the technology boom has made these and other practices almost obsolete. Whereas media came to a press conference and received a press release as well as asked questions, today they check social media and emailed copies of press releases. Company handbooks, orientation/training, and bulletin boards have all moved to the online environment; opportunities for face-to-face communication have dwindled in many workplaces. Those who want or need face-to-face interaction must seek out opportunities and those who prefer to remain isolated may choose to remain behind their computer screen and still fulfill their assigned roles. These online environments have changed how people learn to write in business contexts as well. The 140-character limit for a tweet creates more informal messages that rarely adhere to formal grammar rules. Corporate web pages still maintain the level of formality found in traditional business and professional communication writing instruction; however, the interactive aspects of a website and social media platforms have toned down the formality in an attempt to connect with as many people as possible around the world. Automated language translation programs

make those international connections easier as they allow any website to be converted to a language understandable to any and all. What is not as easily navigated in the online environment, and what has not been added to the business and professional curriculum, is how to design websites that are accessible to those with hearing or sight impairments. The continually evolving nature of technology requires careful consideration in both the instruction and practice realms of business and professional communication.

Future Practice and Research

Understanding the effectiveness of business communication sometimes requires employees to go undercover as they seek to understand betterthe business' current and desired culture. They must continually strive to understand the ways in which face-to-face and mediated messages impact employees and other stakeholders. What works at one point in time with a particular group of people may or may not work the next time with a similar group of people. Effective leaders and followers understand the importance of crafting competent, strategic messages designed with the audience, rather than the message crafter, taking center stage. That is, employees do not enter companies with a ready-made toolbox of messages for delivering bad news about a poor group performance; they must see how others convey similar information and the employees who are listening to the message respond. Understanding their motivations as well as goals helps employees craft the strongest and most impactful messages possible. Moving forward, research in the area of business communication must continue to develop effective strategies and theories for understanding and adapting to the ever-changing local/national/multi-national workplaces and face-to-face/mediated environments employees of the future will enter.

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